

THE PAULI EXCLUSION PRINCIPLE

LEARNING OUTCOMES:

- Define the composition of an atom along with its electrons, neutrons, and protons.
- Explain the Pauli exclusion principle and its application to the atom.
- Specify the shell and subshell symbols and their positions.
- Define the position of electrons in different shells of an atom.
- State the position of each element in the periodic table according to shell filling.

Multiple-Electron Atoms

All atoms except hydrogen are multiple-electron atoms. The physical and chemical properties of elements are directly related to the number of electrons a neutral atom has. The periodic table of the elements groups elements with similar properties into columns. This systematic organization is related to the number of electrons in a neutral atom, called the **atomic number**, Z . We shall see in this section that the exclusion principle is key to the underlying explanations, and that it applies far beyond the realm of atomic physics.

In 1925, the Austrian physicist Wolfgang Pauli (see [Figure 1]) proposed the following rule: No two electrons can have the same set of quantum numbers. That is, no two electrons can be in the same state. This statement is known as the **Pauli exclusion principle**, because it excludes electrons from being in the same state. The Pauli exclusion principle is extremely powerful and very broadly applicable. It applies to any identical particles with half-integral intrinsic spin—that is, having $s = 1/2, 3/2, \dots$. Thus no two electrons can have the same set of quantum numbers.

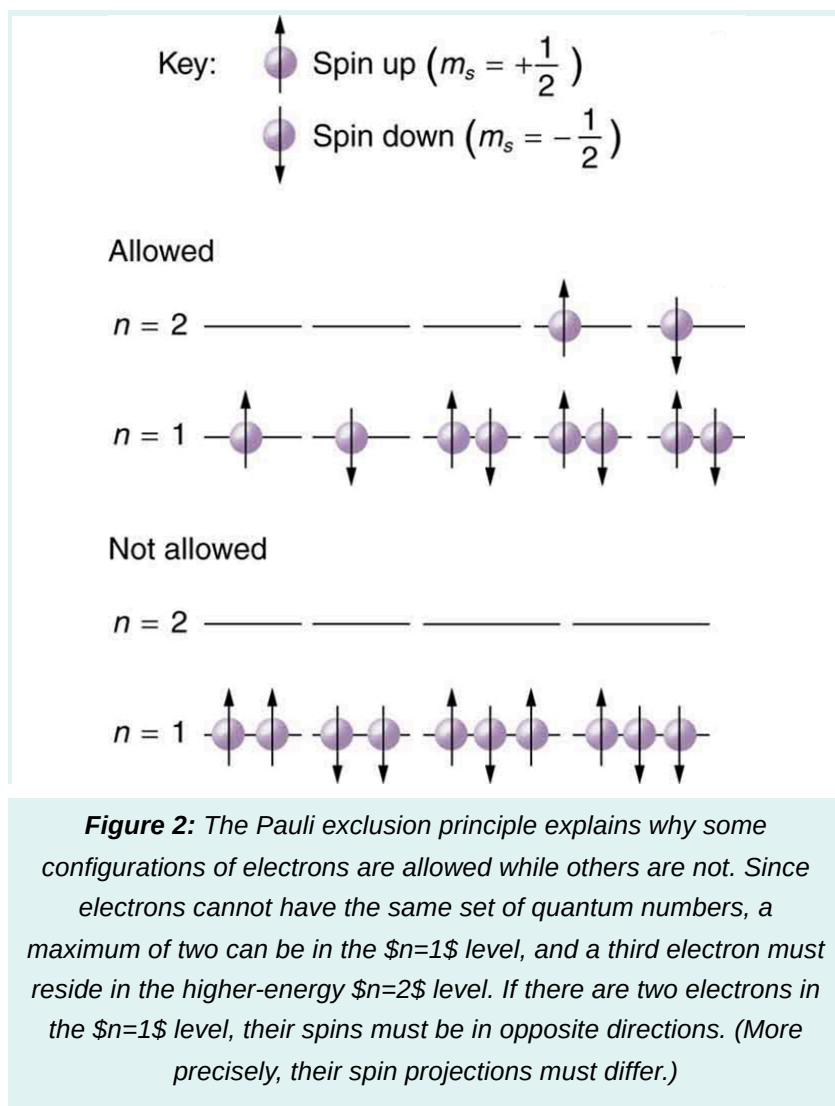
PAULI EXCLUSION PRINCIPLE

No two electrons can have the same set of quantum numbers. That is, no two electrons can be in the same state.



Figure 1: The Austrian physicist Wolfgang Pauli (1900–1958) played a major role in the development of quantum mechanics. He proposed the exclusion principle; hypothesized the existence of an important particle, called the neutrino, before it was directly observed; made fundamental contributions to several areas of theoretical physics; and influenced many students who went on to do important work of their own. (credit: Nobel Foundation, via Wikimedia Commons)

Let us examine how the exclusion principle applies to electrons in atoms. The quantum numbers involved were defined in [Quantum Numbers and Rules](#) as n, l, m_l, s , and m_s . Since s is always $1/2$ for electrons, it is redundant to list s , and so we omit it and specify the state of an electron by a set of four numbers (n, l, m_l, m_s) . For example, the quantum numbers $(2, 1, 0, -1/2)$ completely specify the state of an electron in an atom. Since no two electrons can have the same set of quantum numbers, there are limits to how many of them can be in the same energy state. Note that n determines the energy state in the absence of a magnetic field. So we first choose n , and then we see how many electrons can be in this energy state or energy level. Consider the $n = 1$ level, for example. The only value l can have is 0 (see [Table 1](#) for a list of possible values once n is known), and thus m_l can only be 0. The spin projection m_s can be either $+1/2$ or $-1/2$, and so there can be two electrons in the $n = 1$ state. One has quantum numbers $(1, 0, 0, +1/2)$, and the other has $(1, 0, 0, -1/2)$. [\[Figure 2\]](#) illustrates that there can be one or two electrons having $n = 1$, but not three.



Shells and Subshells

Because of the Pauli exclusion principle, only hydrogen and helium can have all of their electrons in the $n = 1$ state. Lithium (see the periodic table) has three electrons, and so one must be in the $n = 2$ level. This leads to the concept of shells and shell filling. As we progress up in the number of electrons, we go from hydrogen to helium, lithium, beryllium, boron, and so on, and we see that there are limits to the number of electrons for each value of n . Higher values of the shell n correspond to higher energies, and they can allow more electrons because of the various combinations of l , m_l , and m_s that are possible. Each value of the principal quantum number n thus corresponds to an atomic **shell** into which a limited number of electrons can go. Shells and the number of electrons in them determine the physical and chemical properties of atoms, since it is the outermost electrons that interact most with anything outside the atom.

The probability clouds of electrons with the lowest value of l are closest to the nucleus and, thus, more tightly bound. Thus when shells fill, they start with $l = 0$, progress to $l = 1$, and so on. Each value of l thus corresponds to a **subshell**.

The table given below lists symbols traditionally used to denote shells and subshells.

Shell and Subshell Symbols

Shell	Subshell	
n	l	Symbol
1	0	s
2	1	p
3	2	d
4	3	f
5	4	g
	5	h
	$6^{\frac{1}{2}}$	i

To denote shells and subshells, we write nl with a number for n and a letter for l . For example, an electron in the $n = 1$ state must have $l = 0$, and it is denoted as a $1s$ electron. Two electrons in the $n = 1$ state is denoted as $1s^2$. Another example is an electron in the $n = 2$ state with $l = 1$, written as $2p$. The case of three electrons with these quantum numbers is written $2p^3$. This notation, called spectroscopic notation, is generalized as shown in [Figure 3].

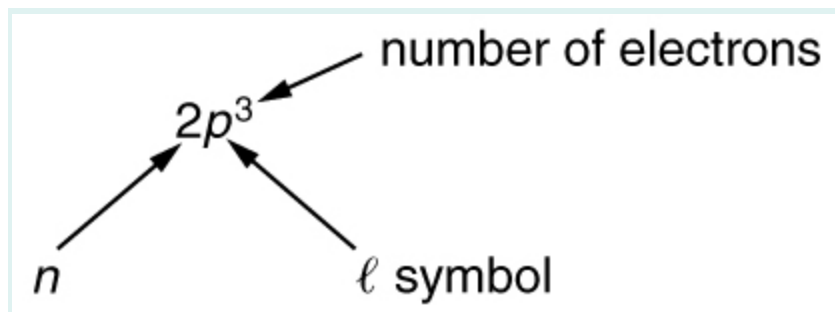


Figure 3:

Counting the number of possible combinations of quantum numbers allowed by the exclusion principle, we can determine how many electrons it takes to fill each subshell and shell.

Example 1: How Many Electrons Can Be in This Shell?

List all the possible sets of quantum numbers for the $n = 2$ shell, and determine the number of electrons that can be in the shell and each of its subshells.

Strategy

Given $n = 2$ for the shell, the rules for quantum numbers limit l to be 0 or 1. The shell therefore has two subshells, labeled $2s$ and $2p$. Since the lowest l subshell fills first, we start with the $2s$ subshell possibilities and then proceed with the $2p$ subshell.

Solution

It is convenient to list the possible quantum numbers in a table, as shown below.

n	ℓ	m_l	m_s	Subshell	Total in subshell	Total in shell
2	0	0	+1/2	2s	2	8
2	0	0	-1/2			
2	1	1	+1/2	2p	6	
2	1	1	-1/2			
2	1	0	+1/2			
2	1	0	-1/2			
2	1	-1	+1/2			
2	1	-1	-1/2			

Figure 4:

Discussion

It is laborious to make a table like this every time we want to know how many electrons can be in a shell or subshell. There exist general rules that are easy to apply, as we shall now see.

The number of electrons that can be in a subshell depends entirely on the value of l . Once l is known, there are a fixed number of values of m_ℓ , each of which can have two values for m_s . First, since m_ℓ goes from $-l$ to l in steps of 1, there are $2l + 1$ possibilities. This number is multiplied by 2, since each electron can be spin up or spin down. Thus the *maximum number of electrons that can be in a subshell* is $2(2l + 1)$.

For example, the $2s$ subshell in [Figure 4] has a maximum of 2 electrons in it, since $2(2l + 1) = 2(0 + 1) = 2$ for this subshell. Similarly, the $2p$ subshell has a maximum of 6 electrons, since $2(2l + 1) = 2(2 + 1) = 6$. For a shell, the maximum number is the sum of what can fit in the subshells. Some algebra shows that the *maximum number of electrons that can be in a shell* is $2n^2$.

For example, for the first shell $n = 1$, and so $2n^2 = 2$. We have already seen that only two electrons can be in the $n = 1$ shell. Similarly, for the second shell, $n = 2$, and so $2n^2 = 8$. As found in [Figure 4], the total number of electrons in the $n = 2$ shell is 8.

Example 2: Subshells and Totals for

$$n = 3$$

How many subshells are in the $n = 3$ shell? Identify each subshell, calculate the maximum number of electrons that will fit into each, and verify that the total is $2n^2$.

Strategy

Subshells are determined by the value of l ; thus, we first determine which values of l are allowed, and then we apply the equation “maximum number of electrons that can be in a subshell = $2(2l + 1)$ ” to find the number of electrons in each subshell.

Solution

Since $n = 3$, we know that l can be 0, 1, or 2; thus, there are three possible subshells. In standard notation, they are labeled the $3s$, $3p$, and $3d$ subshells. We have already seen that 2 electrons can be in an s state, and 6 in a p state, but let us use the equation “maximum number of electrons that can be in a subshell = $2(2l + 1)$ ” to calculate the maximum number in each:

$$\begin{aligned} 3s \text{ has } l = 0; \text{ thus, } 2(2l + 1) &= 2(0 + 1) = 2 && \text{Eq.(1)} \\ 3p \text{ has } l = 1; \text{ thus, } 2(2l + 1) &= 2(2 + 1) = 6 \\ 3d \text{ has } l = 2; \text{ thus, } 2(2l + 1) &= 2(4 + 1) = 10 \\ \text{Total} &= 18 \\ &(\text{in the } n = 3 \text{ shell}) \end{aligned}$$

The equation “maximum number of electrons that can be in a shell = $2n^2$ ” gives the maximum number in the $n = 3$ shell to be

$$\text{Maximum number of electrons} = 2n^2 = 2(3)^2 = 2(9) = 18. \quad \text{Eq.(2)}$$

Discussion

The total number of electrons in the three possible subshells is thus the same as the formula $2n^2$. In standard (spectroscopic) notation, a filled $n = 3$ shell is denoted as $3s^2 3p^6 3d^{10}$. Shells do not fill in a simple manner. Before the $n = 3$ shell is completely filled, for example, we begin to find electrons in the $n = 4$ shell.

Shell Filling and the Periodic Table

[Table 2] shows electron configurations for the first 20 elements in the periodic table, starting with hydrogen and its single electron and ending with calcium. The Pauli exclusion principle determines the maximum number of electrons allowed in each shell and subshell. But the order in which the shells and subshells are filled is complicated because of the large numbers of interactions between electrons.

Electron Configurations of Elements Hydrogen Through Calcium

Element	Number of electrons (Z)	Ground state configuration					
H	1	$1s^1$					
He	2	$1s^2$					
Li	3	$1s^2$	$2s^1$				
Be	4	"	$2s^2$				
B	5	"	$2s^2$	$2p^1$			
C	6	"	$2s^2$	$2p^2$			
N	7	"	$2s^2$	$2p^3$			
O	8	"	$2s^2$	$2p^4$			
F	9	"	$2s^2$	$2p^5$			
Ne	10	"	$2s^2$	$2p^6$			
Na	11	"	$2s^2$	$2p^6$	$3s^1$		
Mg	12	"	"	"	$3s^2$		
Al	13	"	"	"	$3s^2$	$3p^1$	
Si	14	"	"	"	$3s^2$	$3p^2$	
P	15	"	"	"	$3s^2$	$3p^3$	

Element	Number of electrons (Z)	Ground state configuration					
S	16	"	"	"	$3s^2$	$3p^4$	
Cl	17	"	"	"	$3s^2$	$3p^5$	
Ar	18	"	"	"	$3s^2$	$3p^6$	
K	19	"	"	"	$3s^2$	$3p^6$	$4s^1$
Ca	20	"	"	"	"	"	$4s^2$

Examining the above table, you can see that as the number of electrons in an atom increases from 1 in hydrogen to 2 in helium and so on, the lowest-energy shell gets filled first—that is, the $n = 1$ shell fills first, and then the $n = 2$ shell begins to fill. Within a shell, the subshells fill starting with the lowest l , or with the s subshell, then the p , and so on, usually until all subshells are filled. The first exception to this occurs for potassium, where the $4s$ subshell begins to fill before any electrons go into the $3d$ subshell. The next exception is not shown in [Table 2]; it occurs for rubidium, where the $5s$ subshell starts to fill before the $4d$ subshell. The reason for these exceptions is that $l = 0$ electrons have probability clouds that penetrate closer to the nucleus and, thus, are more tightly bound (lower in energy).

[Figure 5] shows the periodic table of the elements, through element 118. Of special interest are elements in the main groups, namely, those in the columns numbered 1, 2, 13, 14, 15, 16, 17, and 18.

PERIODIC TABLE
Atomic Properties of the Elements

NIST
National Institute of
Standards and Technology
U.S. Department of Commerce

Frequently used fundamental physical constants
For the most accurate values of these and other constants, visit physics.nist.gov/constants
1 second = 9 192 631 770 periods of radiation corresponding to the transition between the two hyperfine levels of the ground state of ^{133}Cs (exact)
speed of light in vacuum c $2.997\,924\,58 \times 10^8 \text{ m s}^{-1}$ (exact)
Planck constant h $6.626\,069\,57 \times 10^{-34} \text{ J s}$ (exact)
elementary charge e $1.602\,176\,634 \times 10^{-19} \text{ C}$ (exact)
electron mass m_e $9.109\,383\,56 \times 10^{-31} \text{ kg}$
proton mass m_p $1.672\,621\,637 \times 10^{-27} \text{ kg}$
fine-structure constant α $7.297\,352\,5696 \times 10^{-3}$
Rydberg constant R_∞ $1.097\,373\,156\,850\,8 \times 10^7 \text{ m}^{-1}$
Boltzmann constant k_B $1.380\,650\,4 \times 10^{-23} \text{ J K}^{-1}$

Physics Laboratory
Standard Reference Data
www.nist.gov/srd

Legend:
Solids (blue)
Liquids (green)
Gases (yellow)
Artificially Prepared (pink)

Group	1	2	3	4	5	6	7	8	9	10	11	12	13	14	15	16	17	18
Period	1 H 1.00794	2 He 4.002602																
2	3 Li 6.941	4 Be 9.012182	5 B 10.811	6 C 12.011	7 N 14.00643	8 O 15.9994	9 F 18.998403	10 Ne 20.1797										
3	11 Na 22.989769	12 Mg 24.304	13 Al 26.981538	14 Si 28.08558	15 P 30.973762	16 S 32.06	17 Cl 35.453	18 Ar 39.948										
4	19 K 39.0983	20 Ca 40.078	21 Sc 44.955912	22 Ti 47.88	23 V 50.9415	24 Cr 51.9961	25 Mn 54.938045	26 Fe 55.845	27 Co 58.933195	28 Ni 58.6934	29 Cu 63.546	30 Zn 65.38	31 Ga 69.723	32 Ge 72.64	33 As 74.92160	34 Se 78.96	35 Br 79.904	36 Kr 83.798
5	37 Rb 85.468	38 Sr 87.62	39 Y 88.905848	40 Zr 91.224	41 Nb 92.90638	42 Mo 95.94	43 Tc 98	44 Ru 101.07	45 Rh 102.90550	46 Pd 106.42	47 Ag 107.8682	48 Cd 112.411	49 In 114.818	50 Sn 118.710	51 Sb 121.757	52 Te 127.60	53 I 126.90547	54 Xe 131.29
6	55 Cs 132.9054519	56 Ba 137.327	57 La 138.90471	58 Ce 140.12	59 Pr 140.90765	60 Nd 144.242	61 Pm 144.9127	62 Sm 150.36	63 Eu 151.964	64 Gd 157.25	65 Tb 158.92535	66 Dy 162.500	67 Ho 164.93032	68 Er 167.259	69 Tm 168.93002	70 Yb 173.054	71 Lu 174.967	72 Hf 178.49
7	87 Fr 223	88 Ra 226	89 Ac 227	90 Th 232.0377	91 Pa 231.03688	92 U 238.02891	93 Np 237	94 Pu 244	95 Am 243	96 Cm 247	97 Bk 247	98 Cf 251	99 Es 252	100 Fm 257	101 Md 258	102 No 259	103 Lr 262	104 Rf 261
	Atomic Number Symbol Name Atomic Weight Ground-state Ionization Energy (eV) Ground-state Configuration Ground-state Energy (eV) Based upon ^{12}C. $\circ$ indicates the mass number of the longest-lived isotope. For a description of the data, visit physics.nist.gov/data NIST SP 966 (September 2010)																	

Figure 5: Periodic table of the elements (credit: National Institute of Standards and Technology, U.S. Department of Commerce)

The number of electrons in the outermost subshell determines the atom's chemical properties, since it is these electrons that are farthest from the nucleus and thus interact most with other atoms. If the outermost subshell can accept or give up an electron easily, then the atom will be highly reactive chemically. Each group in the periodic table is characterized by its outermost electron configuration. Perhaps the most familiar is Group 18 (Group VIII), the noble gases (helium, neon, argon, etc.). These gases are all characterized by a filled outer subshell that is particularly stable. This means that they have large ionization energies and do not readily give up an electron. Furthermore, if they were to accept an extra electron, it would be in a significantly higher level and thus loosely bound. Chemical reactions often involve sharing electrons. Noble gases can be forced into unstable chemical compounds only under high pressure and temperature.

Group 17 (Group VII) contains the halogens, such as fluorine, chlorine, iodine and bromine, each of which has one less electron than a neighboring noble gas. Each halogen has 5 p electrons (a p^5 configuration), while the p subshell can hold 6 electrons. This means the halogens have one vacancy in their outermost subshell. They thus readily accept an extra electron (it becomes tightly bound, closing the shell as in noble gases) and are highly reactive chemically. The halogens are also likely to form singly negative ions, such as Cl^- , fitting an extra electron into the vacancy in the outer subshell. In contrast, alkali metals, such as sodium and potassium, all have a single s electron in their outermost subshell (an s^1 configuration) and are members of Group 1 (Group I). These elements easily give up their extra electron and are thus highly reactive chemically. As you might expect, they also tend to form singly positive ions, such as Na^+

, by losing their loosely bound outermost electron. They are metals (conductors), because the loosely bound outer electron can move freely.

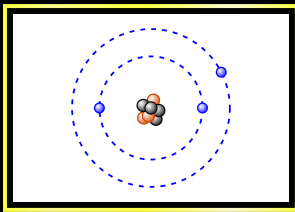
Of course, other groups are also of interest. Carbon, silicon, and germanium, for example, have similar chemistries and are in Group 4 (Group IV). Carbon, in particular, is extraordinary in its ability to form many types of bonds and to be part of long chains, such as inorganic molecules. The large group of elements are called

transitional elements is characterized by the filling of the d subshells and crossing of energy levels. Heavier groups, such as the lanthanide series, are more complex—their shells do not fill in simple order. But the groups recognized by chemists such as Mendeleev have an explanation in the substructure of atoms.

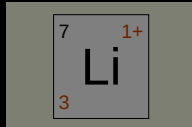
PhET Explorations: Stern-Gerlach Experiment

Build an atom out of protons, neutrons, and electrons, and see how the element, charge, and mass change. Then play a game to test your ideas!

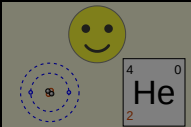
Build an Atom



Atom



Symbol



Game

Section Summary

- The state of a system is completely described by a complete set of quantum numbers. This set is written as (n, l, m_l, m_s) .
- The Pauli exclusion principle says that no two electrons can have the same set of quantum numbers; that is, no two electrons can be in the same state.
- This exclusion limits the number of electrons in atomic shells and subshells. Each value of n corresponds to a shell, and each value of l corresponds to a subshell.
- The maximum number of electrons that can be in a subshell is $2(2l + 1)$.
- The maximum number of electrons that can be in a shell is $2n^2$.

Conceptual Questions

Exercise 1

Identify the shell, subshell, and number of electrons for the following: (a) $2p^3$. (b) $4d^9$. (c) $3s^1$. (d) $5g^{16}$.

Exercise 2

Which of the following are not allowed? State which rule is violated for any that are not allowed.
(a) $1p^3$ (b) $2p^8$ (c) $3g^{11}$ (d) $4f^2$

Problem Exercises

Exercise 3

- (a) How many electrons can be in the $n = 4$ shell?
- (b) What are its subshells, and how many electrons can be in each?

Exercise 4

- (a) What is the minimum value of l for a subshell that has 11 electrons in it?
- (b) If this subshell is in the $n = 5$ shell, what is the spectroscopic notation for this atom?

Exercise 5

(a) If one subshell of an atom has 9 electrons in it, what is the minimum value of l ? (b) What is the spectroscopic notation for this atom, if this subshell is part of the $n = 3$ shell?

Exercise 6

(a) List all possible sets of quantum numbers (n, l, m_l, m_s) for the $n = 3$ shell, and determine the number of electrons that can be in the shell and each of its subshells.

(b) Show that the number of electrons in the shell equals $2n^2$ and that the number in each subshell is $2(2l + 1)$.

Exercise 7

Which of the following spectroscopic notations are not allowed? (a) $5s^1$ (b) $1d^1$ (c) $4s^3$ (d) $3p^7$ (e) $5g^{15}$. State which rule is violated for each that is not allowed.

Exercise 8

Which of the following spectroscopic notations are allowed (that is, which violate none of the rules regarding values of quantum numbers)? (a) $1s^1$ (b) $1d^3$ (c) $4s^2$ (d) $3p^7$ (e) $6h^{20}$

Exercise 9

- (a) Using the Pauli exclusion principle and the rules relating the allowed values of the quantum numbers (n, l, m_l, m_s) , prove that the maximum number of electrons in a subshell is $2n^2$.
- (b) In a similar manner, prove that the maximum number of electrons in a shell is $2n^2$.

Exercise 10**Integrated Concepts**

Estimate the density of a nucleus by calculating the density of a proton, taking it to be a sphere 1.2 fm in diameter. Compare your result with the value estimated in this chapter.

Exercise 11**Integrated Concepts**

The electric and magnetic forces on an electron in the CRT in [Figure 4] are supposed to be in opposite directions. Verify this by determining the direction of each force for the situation shown. Explain how you obtain the directions (that is, identify the rules used).

Exercise 12

- (a) What is the distance between the slits of a diffraction grating that produces a first-order maximum for the first Balmer line at an angle of 20.0° ?
- (b) At what angle will the fourth line of the Balmer series appear in first order?
- (c) At what angle will the second-order maximum be for the first line?

Exercise 13**Integrated Concepts**

A galaxy moving away from the earth has a speed of $0.0100c$. What wavelength do we observe for an $n_i = 7$ to $n_f = 2$ transition for hydrogen in that galaxy?

Exercise 14**Integrated Concepts**

Calculate the velocity of a star moving relative to the earth if you observe a wavelength of 91.0 nm for ionized hydrogen capturing an electron directly into the lowest orbital (that is, a $n_i = \infty$ to $n_f = 1$, or a Lyman series transition).

Exercise 15**Integrated Concepts**

In a Millikan oil-drop experiment using a setup like that in [\[Figure 6\]](#), a 500-V potential difference is applied to plates separated by 2.50 cm. (a) What is the mass of an oil drop having two extra electrons that is suspended motionless by the field between the plates? (b) What is the diameter of the drop, assuming it is a sphere with the density of olive oil?

Exercise 16**Integrated Concepts**

What double-slit separation would produce a first-order maximum at 3.00° for 25.0-keV X-rays? The small answer indicates that the wave character of X-rays is best determined by having them interact with very small objects such as atoms and molecules.

Exercise 17**Integrated Concepts**

In a laboratory experiment designed to duplicate Thomson's determination of q_e/m_e , a beam of electrons having a velocity of $6.00 \times 10^7 \text{ m/s}$ enters a $5.00 \times 10^{-3} \text{ T}$ magnetic field. The beam moves perpendicular to the field in a path having a 6.80-cm radius of curvature. Determine q_e/m_e from these observations, and compare the result with the known value.

Exercise 18**Integrated Concepts**

Find the value of l , the orbital angular momentum quantum number, for the moon around the earth. The extremely large value obtained implies that it is impossible to tell the difference between adjacent quantized orbits for macroscopic objects.

Exercise 19

Integrated Concepts

Particles called muons exist in cosmic rays and can be created in particle accelerators. Muons are very similar to electrons, having the same charge and spin, but they have a mass 207 times greater. When muons are captured by an atom, they orbit just like an electron but with a smaller radius, since the mass in $a_B = \frac{h^2}{4\pi^2 m_e k q_e^2} = 0.529 \times 10^{-10} \text{ m}$ is $207 m_e$.

- (a) Calculate the radius of the $n = 1$ orbit for a muon in a uranium ion ($Z = 92$).
- (b) Compare this with the 7.5-fm radius of a uranium nucleus. Note that since the muon orbits inside the electron, it falls into a hydrogen-like orbit. Since your answer is less than the radius of the nucleus, you can see that the photons emitted as the muon falls into its lowest orbit can give information about the nucleus.

Exercise 20

Integrated Concepts

Calculate the minimum amount of energy in joules needed to create a population inversion in a helium-neon laser containing 1.00×10^{-4} moles of neon.

Exercise 21

Integrated Concepts

A carbon dioxide laser used in surgery emits infrared radiation with a wavelength of $10.6 \mu\text{m}$. In 1.00 ms, this laser raised the temperature of 1.00 cm^3 of flesh to 100°C and evaporated it.

- (a) How many photons were required? You may assume flesh has the same heat of vaporization as water. (b) What was the minimum power output during the flash?

Exercise 22**Integrated Concepts**

Suppose an MRI scanner uses 100-MHz radio waves.

- (a) Calculate the photon energy.
- (b) How does this compare to typical molecular binding energies?

Exercise 23**Integrated Concepts**

- (a) An excimer laser used for vision correction emits 193-nm UV. Calculate the photon energy in eV.
- (b) These photons are used to evaporate corneal tissue, which is very similar to water in its properties. Calculate the amount of energy needed per molecule of water to make the phase change from liquid to gas. That is, divide the heat of vaporization in kJ/kg by the number of water molecules in a kilogram.
- (c) Convert this to eV and compare to the photon energy. Discuss the implications.

Exercise 24**Integrated Concepts**

A neighboring galaxy rotates on its axis so that stars on one side move toward us as fast as 200 km/s, while those on the other side move away as fast as 200 km/s. This causes the EM radiation we receive to be Doppler shifted by velocities over the entire range of ± 200 km/s. What range of wavelengths will we observe for the 656.0-nm line in the Balmer series of hydrogen emitted by stars in this galaxy. (This is called line broadening.)

Exercise 25**Integrated Concepts**

A pulsar is a rapidly spinning remnant of a supernova. It rotates on its axis, sweeping hydrogen along with it so that hydrogen on one side moves toward us as fast as 50.0 km/s, while that on the other side moves away as fast as 50.0 km/s. This means that the EM radiation we receive will be Doppler shifted over a range of $\pm 50.0 \text{ km/s}$. What range of wavelengths will we observe for the 91.20-nm line in the Lyman series of hydrogen? (Such line broadening is observed and actually provides part of the evidence for rapid rotation.)

Exercise 26**Integrated Concepts**

Prove that the velocity of charged particles moving along a straight path through perpendicular electric and magnetic fields is $v = E/B$. Thus crossed electric and magnetic fields can be used as a velocity selector independent of the charge and mass of the particle involved.

Exercise 27**Unreasonable Results**

(a) What voltage must be applied to an X-ray tube to obtain 0.0100-fm-wavelength X-rays for use in exploring the details of nuclei? (b) What is unreasonable about this result? (c) Which assumptions are unreasonable or inconsistent?

Exercise 28**Unreasonable Results**

A student in a physics laboratory observes a hydrogen spectrum with a diffraction grating for the purpose of measuring the wavelengths of the emitted radiation. In the spectrum, she observes a yellow line and finds its wavelength to be 589 nm. (a) Assuming this is part of the Balmer series, determine n_i , the principal quantum number of the initial state. (b) What is unreasonable about this result? (c) Which assumptions are unreasonable or inconsistent?

Exercise 29**Construct Your Own Problem**

The solar corona is so hot that most atoms in it are ionized. Consider a hydrogen-like atom in the corona that has only a single electron. Construct a problem in which you calculate selected spectral energies and wavelengths of the Lyman, Balmer, or other series of this atom that could be used to identify its presence in a very hot gas. You will need to choose the atomic number of the atom, identify the element, and choose which spectral lines to consider.

Exercise 30**Construct Your Own Problem**

Consider the Doppler-shifted hydrogen spectrum received from a rapidly receding galaxy. Construct a problem in which you calculate the energies of selected spectral lines in the Balmer series and examine whether they can be described with a formula like that in the equation $\frac{1}{\lambda} = R \left(\frac{1}{n_f^2} - \frac{1}{n_i^2} \right)$, but with a different constant R .

Footnotes

- 1 It is unusual to deal with subshells having l greater than 6, but when encountered, they continue to be labeled in alphabetical order. { data-list-type="bulleted" data-bullet-style="none" }

GLOSSARY

atomic number

the number of protons in the nucleus of an atom

Pauli exclusion principle

a principle that states that no two electrons can have the same set of quantum numbers; that is, no two electrons can be in the same state

shell

a probability cloud for electrons that has a single principal quantum number

subshell

the probability cloud for electrons that has a single angular momentum quantum number l



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